

ECON 2316 • MICROECONOMIC THEORY

Part II in Formulas

The calculus behind Chapters 4–6 — every key equation, in plain English

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First: meet the new symbols

Five symbols carry the consumer model. Here is what each one is really saying.

$$U(x_1, x_2)$$

A utility function. A score for each bundle — only the ranking matters, not the number itself.

$$MU_i = \frac{\partial U}{\partial x_i}$$

Marginal utility. The next-unit move from Ch 1, now with a partial derivative because utility depends on two goods.

$$\text{MRS}$$

Marginal rate of substitution. The slope of an indifference curve — how much of good 2 the consumer would swap for one more unit of good 1.

$$\lambda$$

The Lagrange multiplier. The shadow price of the budget — how many extra “utils” one more dollar of income would buy.

$$h(p, \bar{u}), e(p, \bar{u})$$

Hicksian demand & expenditure. The cheapest way to hit a fixed utility level — the “dual” problem that powers the Slutsky equation.

Every formula in this deck is built from those five ideas, plus the calculus tools from Part I.

NEW MOVE 1 OF 5

Multivariable Utility — MU & MRS

Partial derivatives, but now they score “the next unit of this good.”

Marginal utility — the partial derivative of U

MULTIVARIABLE UTILITY

Ch 4 • §4.2

$$MU_1 = \frac{\partial U(x_1, x_2)}{\partial x_1}, \quad MU_2 = \frac{\partial U(x_1, x_2)}{\partial x_2}$$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Same idea as marginal cost from Ch 1 — the slope of a total. Utility now depends on two goods, so the partial derivative tells you the boost from one more unit of good i **holding the other good fixed**.

Diminishing MU just means the curve flattens out: $\partial MU_i / \partial x_i < 0$. The third bite of pizza beats the eighth.

MRS — the slope of an indifference curve

$$\text{MRS}_{1,2} = - \left. \frac{dx_2}{dx_1} \right|_{U=\bar{U}} = \frac{MU_1}{MU_2}$$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Walk along an indifference curve. To stay at the same utility, every extra unit of good 1 has to be paid for with some loss of good 2 — that trade-off rate is the MRS. **Implicit differentiation** of $U(x_1, x_2) = \bar{U}$ gives the clean ratio MU_1/MU_2 .

Convex preferences $\Rightarrow$ MRS falls as you move down the curve: the more you already have of good 1, the less of good 2 you'd give up for another unit.

Monotonic transformations — same preferences, same MRS

MULTIVARIABLE UTILITY

Ch 4 • §4.4

$$V = f(U(x_1, x_2)), \quad f' > 0 \quad \Rightarrow \quad \text{MRS}_V = \frac{f'(U) MU}{f'(U) MU}$$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Re-scale utility — take a log, add a constant, square it — and the **chain-rule factor cancels** from numerator and denominator of the MRS. Same indifference curves, same choices. Utility numbers are arbitrary; ratios of marginal utilities are not.

This is the formal reason “utility is ordinal.” The economics lives in the ranking, not in the level.

NEW MOVE 2 OF 5

The Four Canonical Utility Families

Different shapes of indifference curve, different stories about substitutability.

One template, four shapes

UTILITY FAMILIES

Ch 4 • §4.5

$$U = x_1^\alpha x_2^{1-\alpha}$$

Cobb-Douglas — smooth tradeoff

$$U = a x_1 + b x_2$$

Perfect substitutes — constant MRS

$$U = \min(a x_1, b x_2)$$

Perfect complements — L-shaped, kink at the ridge

$$U = v(x_1) + x_2$$

Quasilinear — linear in good 2

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Goods that swap smoothly use Cobb-Douglas; goods that are interchangeable (store-brand sugar) use perfect substitutes; goods that go together (left/right shoes) use perfect complements; one good with constant marginal value (extra dollar at the end of the month) is quasilinear. **Each family pins down a specific MRS — and a specific demand curve in Ch 5.**

THE SETUP — THE LIMIT THE CONSUMER CANNOT BREAK

The Budget Constraint

A straight line in (x_1, x_2) space — with two comparative statics already built in.

The budget set — and a free comparative static

BUDGET CONSTRAINT

Ch 5 • §5.1

$$p_1 x_1 + p_2 x_2 \leq I, \quad \text{slope} = - \frac{p_1}{p_2}$$

Demand is homogeneous of degree zero: $x_i^*(kp, kI) = x_i^*(p, I)$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

The budget line is the boundary the consumer cannot cross. A price change **rotates** it; an income change **shifts it parallel**. Scale prices and income by the same factor and nothing moves — only relative prices and real income matter.

This is why economists write p_1/p_2 , not p_1 alone. Inflation by itself is invisible to the model.

NEW MOVE 3 OF 5

Constrained Optimization — The Lagrangian

Part I's $\max f$ s.t. $g \leq 0$, now solved for two goods with one method.

Tangency — two forms of the same rule

OPTIMIZATION

Ch 5 • §5.2

$$\text{MRS} = \frac{MU_1}{MU_2} = \frac{p_1}{p_2}$$

Slope form (the tangency condition)

$$\frac{MU_1}{p_1} = \frac{MU_2}{p_2}$$

Ratio form (equimarginal principle)

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

At the best bundle, the consumer's willingness to trade good 1 for good 2 **matches the market's price ratio**.

Equivalently, the last dollar buys the same amount of extra utility no matter which good you spend it on — otherwise reallocate.

Same idea as Part I's FOC: set the slope of the “goal” equal to the slope of the “limit.”

The Lagrangian — and what λ really is

OPTIMIZATION

Ch 5 • §5.3

$$\mathcal{L}(x_1, x_2, \lambda) = U(x_1, x_2) + \lambda (I - p_1 x_1 - p_2 x_2)$$

$$\text{FOCs: } MU_i = \lambda p_i \text{ for each good } \Rightarrow \lambda = \frac{\partial V}{\partial I} \text{ (marginal utility of income)}$$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

The Lagrangian glues the goal and the limit into one expression. Take partial derivatives, set them to zero, and the tangency rule falls out automatically. The multiplier λ is the **shadow price of the budget**: one more dollar of income would buy λ extra utils.

Same template extends to labor-leisure, time budgets, intertemporal choice — anywhere you maximize something subject to a linear constraint.

Solved templates — what the Lagrangian buys you

MARSHALLIAN DEMAND

Ch 5 • §5.4

$$x_1^* = \frac{\alpha I}{p_1}, \quad x_2^* = \frac{(1 - \alpha) I}{p_2}$$

Cobb-Douglas $U = x_1^\alpha x_2^{1-\alpha}$ — constant expenditure shares

$$v'(x_1^*) = \frac{p_1}{p_2} \Rightarrow \frac{\partial x_1^*}{\partial I} = 0$$

Quasilinear $U = v(x_1) + x_2$ — zero income effect on x_1

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Cobb-Douglas spends a constant **fraction** of income on each good — double income, double quantities. Quasilinear pins x_1^* **only to prices** — extra income flows into good 2 alone. Perfect complements ride the ridge $ax_1 = bx_2$; perfect substitutes pick the cheaper good (a corner).

Memorize these closed forms — they show up in every Ch 5 walkthrough and again in Ch 6's Slutsky decomposition.

NEW MOVE 4 OF 5

Income & Substitution Effects

A price change has two channels. Pulling them apart is the Ch 6 punchline.

Income elasticity — classifying a good

INCOME EFFECTS

Ch 6 • §6.1

$$\varepsilon_I = \frac{\partial x}{\partial I} \cdot \frac{I}{x}$$

Engel curve: $x = x^*(p, I)$ at fixed

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Same template as the demand elasticity from Ch 3 — just with income on the bottom. The Engel curve traces out how purchases of one good move as income rises.

READING THE SIGN OF E_I

$\varepsilon_I > 1$ — **luxury**. Demand rises faster than income.

$0 < \varepsilon_I < 1$ — **necessity**. Demand rises, but more slowly than income.

$\varepsilon_I < 0$ — **inferior**. Demand falls as income rises.

Decomposing a price change — two channels

INCOME & SUBSTITUTION

Ch 6 • §6.2

$$\underbrace{\Delta x_1}_{\text{total effect}} = \underbrace{\Delta x_1^{\text{sub}}}_{\text{substitution effect}} + \underbrace{\Delta x_1^{\text{inc}}}_{\text{income effect}}$$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

When p_1 falls, two things happen at once. Good 1 is **relatively cheaper** — the consumer substitutes toward it (always). And the consumer's **real purchasing power rises** — for a normal good, that boosts demand further; for an inferior good, it pulls the other way.

Sub effect on its own = move along the original indifference curve to the new price ratio. Income effect on its own = parallel shift of the budget to the new purchasing power.

NEW MOVE 5A OF 5

Duality & Hicksian Demand

The same optimum, approached from the other side — minimum spending for a fixed utility.

Primal vs. dual — and Shephard's lemma

DUALITY

Ch 6 • §6.2.3

$$\max_x U(x) \text{ s.t. } p \cdot x \leq I$$

Primal — Marshallian $x^M(p, I)$

$$\min_x p \cdot x \text{ s.t. } U(x) \geq \bar{u}$$

Dual — Hicksian $h(p, \bar{u})$

$$e(p, \bar{u}) = p \cdot h(p, \bar{u}) \qquad h_i(p, \bar{u}) = \frac{\partial e(p, \bar{u})}{\partial p_i}$$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Two questions about the same optimum: “maximize utility on a budget” and “hit a utility level for the least money.” They yield the same bundle. The dual gives you **Hicksian (compensated)** demand — the pure substitution response, with no income channel mixed in. Shephard says: to read the Hicksian, differentiate the cheapest-bundle cost with respect to that good's price.

NEW MOVE 5B OF 5 — THE SYNTHESIZING IDENTITY

The Slutsky Equation

One line that ties Marshallian, Hicksian, income, and the sign chart together.

The Slutsky equation — total = substitution + income

SLUTSKY EQUATION

Ch 6 • §6.3

$$\underbrace{\frac{\partial x_i^M}{\partial p_j}}_{\text{total (Marshallian)}} = \underbrace{\frac{\partial h_i}{\partial p_j}}_{\text{substitution (Hicksian)}} - \underbrace{x_j^M \cdot \frac{\partial x_i^M}{\partial I}}_{\text{income channel}}$$

Own-price substitution is always non-positive: $\partial h_i / \partial p_i \leq 0$

IN PLAIN ENGLISH

Differentiate the duality identity $x_i^M(p, I) = h_i(p, V(p, I))$ and the Slutsky equation falls out. The Marshallian slope you observe in the market is the **pure substitution slope** (always away from the pricier good) **minus** the income channel, weighted by how much of good j the consumer was buying.

Quasilinear preferences have $\partial x_1 / \partial I = 0$, so the income term vanishes and Marshallian = Hicksian. That is why quasilinear is the workhorse for clean welfare math.

Sign chart — normal, inferior, Giffen

SLUTSKY — SIGN CLASSIFICATION

Ch 6 • §6.4

$$\frac{\partial x_1^M}{\partial p_1} = \underbrace{\frac{\partial h_1}{\partial p_1}}_{\leq 0 \text{ always}} - \underbrace{x_1^M \cdot \frac{\partial x_1^M}{\partial I}}_{\text{sign} = \text{sign}(\varepsilon_I)}$$

READING THE TABLE

Normal good

Sub < 0, income channel < 0. **Demand slopes down.**

Inferior good — sub dominates

Sub < 0, income channel > 0. **Demand still slopes down.**

Giffen good — income dominates

Sub < 0, but a large positive income channel flips the sign — **demand slopes up.**

Giffen is rare and requires (i) inferior and (ii) a very large income share — e.g. Jensen-Miller's Hunan rice.

Five new moves. That is the whole consumer model.

Multivariable utility

Partial derivatives in a new role: $MU_i = \partial U / \partial x_i$; slope of an indifference curve $MRS = MU_1 / MU_2$.

Four canonical families

Cobb-Douglas, perfect substitutes, perfect complements, quasilinear — each pins down a specific MRS and a specific demand.

The Lagrangian

Part I's $\max f$ s.t. $g \leq 0$, now mechanized. Tangency $MRS = p_1 / p_2$; λ = shadow price of income.

Income & substitution

Two channels behind every price change. Income elasticity ε_I classifies the good as normal, necessity, luxury, or inferior.

Duality & the Slutsky equation

Hicksian demand $h = \partial e / \partial p$ isolates the substitution channel. Slutsky stitches it back to the Marshallian demand the market actually shows you.

Every chapter from 7 onward — production, costs, market power — reuses these moves with the names changed. Firms maximize profit subject to a production limit, just as consumers maximize utility subject to a budget. The economics changes; the calculus does not.